STA 130A: Mathematical Statistics: Brief Course

Lecture 15: Covariance, Correlation, and Total Variance

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Announcements

Homework 4 is due tomorrow (Thu, Oct 29, 11:59 PM PT)

Extended office hours: Wednesdays, 1–3 PM (MSB 1143)

- The 1–2 PM hour is shared with STA 35C, whose students may receive priority

Agenda

Last time: Derived distributions

- Find the distribution of $Z = g(X)$ using its CDF
- Use the inverse-derivative formula for smooth monotone transformations

Today: Describe dependence and variability without deriving a full distribution

- Covariance and variance of sums
- Correlation
- Conditional variance
- Law of total variance

Recall: Variance

The variance of a random variable X is

$$\mathrm{Var}(X) = \mathbb{E}\left[(X - \mathbb{E}[X])^2\right] = \mathbb{E}[X^2] - (\mathbb{E}[X])^2.$$

- $\mathbb{E}[X]$ measures the center of the distribution
- $\mathrm{Var}(X)$ measures the spread around the center
- $\mathrm{Var}(aX + b) = a^2\mathrm{Var}(X)$

Example (Why dependence matters)

Let $X \sim \mathrm{Bernoulli}(1/2)$.

- If $Y \sim \mathrm{Bernoulli}(1/2)$, independent of X, then $\mathrm{Var}(X + Y) = \mathrm{Var}(X) + \mathrm{Var}(Y) = \frac{1}{2}$.
- If we set $Y = X$. Then $\mathrm{Var}(X + Y) = \mathrm{Var}(2X) = 4\left(\frac{1}{4}\right) = 1$.
  The same fluctuations are counted twice, so the variances do not simply add.

Question: How do we account for the way two variables vary together?

Covariance

Definition (Covariance)

For random variables X and Y, the **covariance** between X and Y is

$$\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y) = \mathbb{E}\big[\,(X - \mathbb{E}[X])(Y - \mathbb{E}[Y])\,\big].$$

Expanding the definition gives the useful computational formula

$$\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y) = \mathbb{E}[XY] - \mathbb{E}[X]\,\mathbb{E}[Y].$$

Interpretation:

- $\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y) > 0$: X and Y tend to move together
- $\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y) < 0$: one tends to be high when the other is low
- $\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y) = 0$: no linear co-movement, but not necessarily independence

Example: Covariance from a small joint table

Example (Illustrative morning/afternoon rain model)

Let X and Y indicate morning and afternoon rain, respectively.

$p_{X,Y}(x,y)$	$y=0$	$y=1$	$p_X(x)$
$x=0$	0.4	0.1	0.5
$x=1$	0.1	0.4	0.5
$p_Y(y)$	0.5	0.5	1

Since $XY = 1$ exactly when both periods have rain,

$$\mathbb{E}[X] = \mathbb{E}[Y] = 0.5, \qquad \mathbb{E}[XY] = 0.4,$$

$$\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y) = 0.4 - (0.5)(0.5) = 0.15.$$

Interpretation: In this model, $P(Y = 1 \mid X = 1) = 0.4/0.5 = 0.8 > 0.5 = P(Y = 1)$.

Self-study: A tunable covariance

Example

Let $p \in [0,1]$. Let X and Y be independent random variables such that

$$X = \begin{cases} 1 & \text{with probability } 1/2, \\ -1 & \text{with probability } 1/2, \end{cases} \quad \text{and} \quad Y = \begin{cases} 1 & \text{with probability } p, \\ -1 & \text{with probability } 1-p, \end{cases}$$

Define $Z = XY$. Observe that

$$\mathbb{E}[X] = 0, \qquad \mathbb{E}[Z] = \mathbb{E}[XY] = \mathbb{E}[X]\mathbb{E}[Y] = 0, \qquad XZ = X(XY) = X^2 Y = Y.$$

Thus,

$$\mathrm{Cov}(X,Z) = \mathbb{E}[XZ] - \mathbb{E}[X]\mathbb{E}[Z] = \mathbb{E}[Y] = 2p - 1.$$

and therefore

$$\mathrm{Cov}(X,Z) \begin{cases} > 0, & p > 1/2, \\ = 0, & p = 1/2, \\ < 0, & p < 1/2. \end{cases}$$

When $p > 1/2$, $Z = XY$ tends to have the same sign as X; when $p < 1/2$, the opposite.

Properties of covariance

For any random variables X, Y, Z and any scalars a, b,

- $\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y) = \mathrm{Cov}(Y, X)$
- $\mathrm{Cov}(X, X) = \mathrm{Var}(X)$
- $\mathrm{Cov}(X, aY + b) = a\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y)$
- $\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y + Z) = \mathrm{Cov}(X, Y) + \mathrm{Cov}(X, Z)$

The variance of a sum of random variables satisfies

$$\mathrm{Var}\left(\sum_{i=1}^{n} X_i\right) = \sum_{i=1}^{n} \mathrm{Var}(X_i) + 2 \sum_{1 \le i < j \le n} \mathrm{Cov}(X_i, X_j).$$

- When $n = 2$,
$$\mathrm{Var}(X + Y) = \mathrm{Var}(X) + \mathrm{Var}(Y) + 2\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y)$$
- Unlike expectations, variances add only when the covariance terms vanish

Example: Variance of a sum and a difference

Example

Suppose

$$\mathrm{Var}(X) = 4, \qquad \mathrm{Var}(Y) = 9, \qquad \mathrm{Cov}(X, Y) = -3.$$

Question: Compute $\mathrm{Var}(X + Y)$ and $\mathrm{Var}(X - Y)$.

Using $\mathrm{Var}(X + Y) = \mathrm{Var}(X) + \mathrm{Var}(Y) + 2\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y)$ and $\mathrm{Cov}(X, -Y) = -\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y)$, we get

$$\begin{aligned}
\mathrm{Var}(X + Y) &= 4 + 9 + 2(-3) = 7, \\
\mathrm{Var}(X - Y) &= \mathrm{Var}(X) + \mathrm{Var}(Y) - 2\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y) \\
&= 4 + 9 - 2(-3) = 19.
\end{aligned}$$

Interpretation: Negative covariance reduces the variability of $X + Y$, but increases the variability of $X - Y$.

Independence and zero covariance

If X and Y are independent, then

$$\mathbb{E}[XY] = \mathbb{E}[X]\mathbb{E}[Y], \qquad \text{and therefore} \qquad \mathrm{Cov}(X, Y) = 0.$$

However, the converse is false:

$$\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y) = 0 \implies X, Y \text{ independent.}$$

Example

Let X be uniform on $\{-1, 0, 1\}$, and let

$$Y = X^2.$$

Then Y is determined by X, so X and Y are not independent.
Nevertheless,

$$\mathbb{E}[X] = 0, \qquad \mathbb{E}[XY] = \mathbb{E}[X^3] = 0, \qquad \text{and hence,} \qquad \mathrm{Cov}(X, Y) = 0.$$

Pop-up quiz: Covariance

Suppose

$$\mathrm{Var}(X) = 4, \qquad \mathrm{Var}(Y) = 9, \qquad \mathrm{Cov}(X, Y) = -3.$$

Question: What is $\mathrm{Var}(2X - Y)$?

A) 7

B) 19

C) 25

D) 37

Answer: D.

$$\begin{aligned}\mathrm{Var}(2X - Y) &= 4\mathrm{Var}(X) + \mathrm{Var}(Y) + 2(2)(-1)\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y) \\ &= 4(4) + 9 - 4(-3) = 37.\end{aligned}$$

Follow-up: What sign of $\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y)$ reduces $\mathrm{Var}(X + Y)$ and $\mathrm{Var}(X - Y)$ respectively?

Correlation coefficient

Definition

When $\mathrm{Var}(X) > 0$ and $\mathrm{Var}(Y) > 0$, the **correlation coefficient** between X and Y is

$$\rho(X, Y) = \frac{\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y)}{\sqrt{\mathrm{Var}(X)\ \mathrm{Var}(Y)}}.$$

Covariance depends on the units of X and Y, but the correlation coefficient normalizes.

- When $\mathrm{Var}(X) > 0$ and $\mathrm{Var}(Y) > 0$,

$$-1 \leq \rho(X, Y) \leq 1.$$

Interpretation:

- $\rho > 0$: positive linear association
- $\rho < 0$: negative linear association
- $\rho = 0$: uncorrelated, but not necessarily independent
- $|\rho| = 1$: exact linear relationship

Example: Correlation under an affine relationship

Example

Let $a, b \in \mathbb{R}$ with $a \neq 0$, and suppose $\mathrm{Var}(X) > 0$ and

$$Y = aX + b.$$

Question: Compute the correlation coefficient between X and Y.

By definition,

$$\begin{aligned} \mathrm{Cov}(X, Y) &= \mathrm{Cov}(X, aX + b) = a\mathrm{Var}(X), \\ \mathrm{Var}(Y) &= a^2\mathrm{Var}(X). \end{aligned}$$

Therefore,

$$\rho(X, Y) = \frac{a\mathrm{Var}(X)}{\sqrt{\mathrm{Var}(X)\, a^2\mathrm{Var}(X)}} = \frac{a}{|a|}. \qquad \text{and thus,} \qquad \rho(X, Y) = \begin{cases} 1, & a > 0, \\ -1, & a < 0. \end{cases}$$

Pop-up quiz: Correlation

Suppose $\rho(X, Y) = 0.6$, and define

$$U = 3X + 1, \qquad V = -2Y + 5.$$

Question: What is $\rho(U, V)$?

A) 0.6
B) -0.6
C) -1.2
D) Cannot be determined

Answer: B.
Adding constants does not change correlation. Multiplying one variable by a negative constant flips the sign:

$$\rho(3X + 1, -2Y + 5) = -\rho(X, Y) = -0.6.$$

Follow-up: What if $V = 2Y + 5$ instead?

Motivation: Conditional uncertainty

Variance measures uncertainty:

$$\mathrm{Var}(X) = \mathbb{E}[(X - \mathbb{E}[X])^2].$$

But if we observe another random variable Y, our uncertainty about X may change.

- $\mathbb{E}[X]$: unconditional center of X
- $\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]$: center of X after observing Y
- $\mathrm{Var}(X)$: unconditional uncertainty
- $\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y)$: remaining uncertainty after observing Y

Goal: decompose total uncertainty in X into what remains after conditioning and what is explained by Y.

Conditional variance

Recall that $\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]$ is a random variable encoding the mean of X after Y is observed.

Similarly, conditional variance measures the remaining spread of X after Y is observed.

Definition

The **conditional variance** of X given $Y = y$ is

$$\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y = y) = \mathbb{E}\left[(X - \mathbb{E}[X \mid Y = y])^2 \mid Y = y\right].$$

Equivalently,

$$\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y = y) = \mathbb{E}[X^2 \mid Y = y] - (\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y = y])^2.$$

The conditional variance $\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y)$ is a random variable

- When $Y = y$, its value is $\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y = y)$.

Example: Conditional variance in a two-group model

Example

Let $Y \sim \text{Bernoulli}(1/2)$. Suppose

$$X \mid Y = 0 \sim N(0, 1), \qquad X \mid Y = 1 \sim N(2, 4).$$

Question: Compute conditional mean and conditional variance for $Y = 0$ and $Y = 1$.

If $Y = 0$, then

$$\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y = 0] = 0, \qquad \text{Var}(X \mid Y = 0) = 1.$$

If $Y = 1$, then

$$\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y = 1] = 2, \qquad \text{Var}(X \mid Y = 1) = 4.$$

Observe that

$$\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y] = 2Y \qquad \text{and} \qquad \text{Var}(X \mid Y) = 1 + 3Y.$$

Interpretation: observing Y reveals which group mean and within-group variance apply.

Note: $\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]$ and $\text{Var}(X \mid Y)$ are random variables as they depend on random label Y

Law of total variance

Theorem (Law of total variance)

$$\mathrm{Var}(X) = \mathbb{E}[\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y)] + \mathrm{Var}(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]).$$

- $\mathbb{E}[\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y)]$: average uncertainty remaining after observing Y.
- $\mathrm{Var}(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y])$: variability explained by how the conditional mean changes with Y.

Interpretation:

total variability = average within-condition variability + between-condition variability.

This is the variance analogue of the law of total expectation:

$$\mathbb{E}[X] = \mathbb{E}\big[\,\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]\,\big].$$

Self-study: Proof of the law of total variance

Theorem (Law of total variance)

$$\mathrm{Var}(X) = \mathbb{E}[\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y)] + \mathrm{Var}(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]).$$

Proof. Let $m(Y) = \mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]$. Then

$$\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y) = \mathbb{E}[X^2 \mid Y] - m(Y)^2.$$

Taking expectations and using the law of total expectation,

$$\mathbb{E}[\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y)] = \mathbb{E}\big[\mathbb{E}[X^2 \mid Y]\big] - \mathbb{E}[m(Y)^2] = \mathbb{E}[X^2] - \mathbb{E}[m(Y)^2]. \tag{1}$$

Also, since $\mathbb{E}[m(Y)] = \mathbb{E}[X]$ by total expectation,

$$\mathrm{Var}(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]) = \mathrm{Var}(m(Y)) = \mathbb{E}[m(Y)^2] - \big(\mathbb{E}[m(Y)]\big)^2 = \mathbb{E}[m(Y)^2] - (\mathbb{E}[X])^2. \tag{2}$$

Adding the two equations (1) and (2) gives

$$\mathbb{E}[\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y)] + \mathrm{Var}(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]) = \mathbb{E}[X^2] - (\mathbb{E}[X])^2 = \mathrm{Var}(X).$$

Example: Total variance in the two-group model

Example

Recall the two-group model:

$$Y \sim \text{Bernoulli}(1/2), \qquad X \mid Y = 0 \sim N(0,1), \qquad X \mid Y = 1 \sim N(2,4).$$

Thus,

$$\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y] = 2Y, \qquad \text{Var}(X \mid Y) = 1 + 3Y.$$

Since $Y \sim \text{Bernoulli}(1/2)$,

$$\mathbb{E}[\text{Var}(X \mid Y)] = \mathbb{E}[1 + 3Y] = 1 + 3 \cdot \frac{1}{2} = \frac{5}{2}.$$

Also,

$$\text{Var}(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]) = \text{Var}(2Y) = 4\text{Var}(Y) = 4 \cdot \frac{1}{4} = 1.$$

Therefore, by the law of total variance,

$$\text{Var}(X) = \frac{5}{2} + 1 = \frac{7}{2}.$$

What “conditioning reduces uncertainty” means

The law of total variance implies

$$\mathbb{E}[\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y)] \leq \mathrm{Var}(X).$$

Thus conditioning reduces uncertainty **on average**.

However, it need not reduce variance for every conditioning value.

- In the two-group example,

$$\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y = 1) = 4 > \frac{7}{2} = \mathrm{Var}(X).$$

Takeaway: Information can identify a particularly variable subgroup even though the average remaining uncertainty is smaller.

Self-study: Resolved vs. remaining variability in estimation

Inverse-problem setting: Suppose X is an unknown quantity of interest, and Y is an observed measurement/data. Before observing Y, uncertainty about X is measured by $\mathrm{Var}(X)$.

Estimation of X given Y: After observing Y, a natural prediction of X is the conditional mean

$$\widehat{X} = \mathbb{E}[X \mid Y].$$

Define the residual $R = X - \widehat{X}$. Then

$$\mathbb{E}[R \mid Y] = \mathbb{E}[X - \mathbb{E}[X \mid Y] \mid Y] = 0.$$

Thus, after using the information in Y, the residual has conditional mean zero.

Moreover, since $\mathbb{E}[R] = 0$, $\mathrm{Var}(R) = \mathbb{E}[R^2]$. Therefore,

$$\mathrm{Var}(\widehat{X}) = \mathrm{Var}(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]) \qquad \text{and} \qquad \mathrm{Var}(R) = \mathbb{E}[R^2] = \mathbb{E}\left[\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y)\right].$$

Therefore, the law of total variance can be read as

$$\mathrm{Var}(X) = \underbrace{\mathrm{Var}(\widehat{X})}_{\text{uncertainty resolved/explained by } Y} + \underbrace{\mathrm{Var}(R)}_{\text{average posterior uncertainty left after } Y}.$$

Message: Observing Y changes the conditional mean $\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]$. The variability of these conditional means is the explained part; the residual term is the average uncertainty left after observing Y.

Self-study: Explained vs. residual variability in regression

Regression setting: Suppose now that

$$Y = \text{response}, \qquad X = \text{predictor}.$$

The conditional mean

$$m(X) = \mathbb{E}[Y \mid X]$$

is the regression function: it gives the mean response after seeing the predictor value.

The law of total variance becomes

$$\mathrm{Var}(Y) = \underbrace{\mathrm{Var}(m(X))}_{\text{variation explained by the predictor}} + \underbrace{\mathbb{E}[\mathrm{Var}(Y \mid X)]}_{\text{average within-predictor noise}}.$$

Interpretation:

- If X is informative, then $m(X)$ changes substantially with X, so $\mathrm{Var}(m(X))$ is large.
- If responses are tightly concentrated around $m(X)$, then $\mathbb{E}[\mathrm{Var}(Y \mid X)]$ is small.

This is the probability-theory version of the familiar idea behind regression:

$$\text{total variation} = \text{explained variation} + \text{residual variation}.$$

Pop-up quiz: Total variance

Suppose that

$$\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y) = 2 \quad \text{for every value of } Y, \qquad \mathbb{E}[X \mid Y] = 3Y, \qquad \mathrm{Var}(Y) = 4.$$

Question: What is $\mathrm{Var}(X)$?

A) 2
B) 6
C) 14
D) 38

Answer: D.
By the law of total variance,

$$\mathrm{Var}(X) = \mathbb{E}[\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y)] + \mathrm{Var}(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]) = 2 + \mathrm{Var}(3Y) = 2 + 9 \cdot 4 = 38.$$

Follow-up: In

$$\mathrm{Var}(X) = \mathbb{E}[\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y)] + \mathrm{Var}(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]),$$

which term becomes small if observing Y makes X almost deterministic?

Wrap-up

Covariance and correlation

$$\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y) = \mathbb{E}[XY] - \mathbb{E}[X]\mathbb{E}[Y], \qquad \rho(X, Y) = \frac{\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y)}{\sqrt{\mathrm{Var}(X)\mathrm{Var}(Y)}}.$$

- $\mathrm{Var}(X + Y) = \mathrm{Var}(X) + \mathrm{Var}(Y) + 2\mathrm{Cov}(X, Y)$
- Independence implies zero covariance; the converse can fail

Conditional and total variance

$$\mathrm{Var}(X) = \mathbb{E}[\mathrm{Var}(X \mid Y)] + \mathrm{Var}(\mathbb{E}[X \mid Y]).$$

- Total variability = average within-condition variability + between-condition variability

Suggested reading: [BT08, Sec. 4.2–4.3]

Next lecture: Moment generating functions and independent sums.

References


Dimitri Bertsekas and John N Tsitsiklis.
Introduction to probability, volume 1.
Athena Scientific, 2nd edition, 2008.